

PAM Waveform Design for Joint Communication and Sensing Based on Visible Light

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Abstract—In this article, we propose a joint communication and sensing (JCAS) waveform design method for pulse amplitude modulation (PAM) signal based on visible light. Common communication and sensing performance metrics, including symbol error rate, achievable transmission rate, miss detection probability, and Kullback–Leibler (KL) divergence, are adopted. We provide an optimization criterion with respect to parameter of the integrated waveform under peak power constraint to balance the communication performance and the sensing performance. We conduct the JCAS experiments for the objects under short distance of 1 m and long distance of 7 m. Both numerical and experimental results show that, for PAM signals, there exists a fundamental tradeoff between the communication performance and the sensing performance. Given the same sampling rate and the same number of samples for target detection, high-order PAM signals provide better sensing performance due to the lower tail probability. Moreover, with longer distances and stronger diffuse reflections, the detection duration needs to be extended to obtain better sensing performance.

Index Terms—Achievable transmission rate, joint communication and sensing (JCAS), Kullback–Leibler (KL) divergence, waveform design.

I. INTRODUCTION

VISIBLE light can serve as an alternative to radio frequency (RF) signals, especially for scenarios sensitive to electromagnetic signals, such as hospitals, cabins, and so on. Due to the widespread use of light-emitting diode (LED) devices and their advantages of fast response, low-power consumption, and long lifetime, the researches on data transmission, positioning, and other aspects based on visible light have developed rapidly [1], [2].

Due to the similarities between the communication system and the sensing system in terms of spectrum, transceiver structure, signal detection, and processing, joint communication and sensing (JCAS) has gained extensive attention [3], [4], [5], [6], [7], [8]. It aims to realize data transmission and

target/environment detection, identification, imaging, etc., by means of spectrum sharing, software and hardware resources sharing, and other ways [9], [10], [11], [12]. The endeavors can be categorized into hardware structure design, waveform design, data processing, and other key technologies, among which the waveform design needs to be investigated [13], [14].

The integrated waveform design in RF spectrum can be divided into three main types. The first type focuses on sensing, where the traditional radar waveforms are modified to achieve communication. Linear frequency modulation waveform with constant-envelope characteristics is widely adopted to embed the communication information by modulating amplitude, phase, and other parameters [15], [16], [17]. In multiple-input–multiple-output (MIMO) system, frequency hopping technology, antenna pattern optimization, and index modulation greatly extend the degree of freedom in integrated waveform design [18], [19], [20]. However, these waveforms have a low communication rate. The second type adopts the communication waveforms for sensing, e.g., orthogonal frequency-division multiplexing (OFDM) signals are adopted to realize JCAS through constellation point optimization, subcarrier and power allocation [21], [22], [23]. However, the randomness of communication information will deteriorate the sensing performance. The third type aims to design waveforms with higher degrees of freedom to realize flexible tradeoff between communication and sensing. Integrated waveforms based on information theory [24] and capacity loss criterion [25], [26], [27] have been proposed, but these waveforms have higher complexity.

Until now, the JCAS based on visible light is in the preliminary research stage. In [28], the integrated waveform for joint communication and frequency estimation of vibrating objects was investigated, where a fundamental compromise between high throughput and wide coverage was demonstrated by adjusting the duty cycle of the strobe light source. Further, the JCAS performance was optimized in [29] for single strobe and multiple strobe cases. Moreover, the integrated waveform for communication and machine frequency estimation in the industrial Internet of Things (IoT) was investigated in [30], where the communication data was transmitted both in on-phase and off-phase of the light source for high throughput with small degradation on sensing performance. In [31], a JCAS system for sensing the rotation angle of a servomotor and sending the necessary commands was practically implemented. The integration problem of sense-prioritized under multiple constraints was studied in [32], where the total

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transmitted power was minimized based on slot selection and power allocation algorithms. More recently, multiband carrierless amplitude and phase (m-CAP) modulation was adopted in [33] to achieve communication and positioning under the constraints of dynamic range and modulation bandwidth of the light source. In [34], the communication and distance estimation were realized simultaneously through pulse sequence sensing and pulse position modulation (PPS-PPM) method, where the sensing performance was comparable to that of a single-pulse laser radar.

In the existing literature, the sensing targets include the space shuttles [4], factory floor robots [28], human bodies [35], etc. However, in visible light-based JCAS systems, the sensing tasks are focused on parameter estimation, while target detection has not been explored. Target detection based on visible light plays an important role in scenarios sensitive to electromagnetic interference. Therefore, we define the sensing task as target detection in the direction of light source illumination in this work.

In this article, we propose an integrated waveform design scheme for communication and target detection based on visible light, which can flexibly balance communication performance and sensing performance by adjusting the parameter of the pulse amplitude modulation (PAM) waveform. First, we analyze the effects of the integrated waveform parameter on common communication and sensing metrics, including symbol error rate (SER), achievable transmission rate, miss detection probability, and Kullback–Leibler (KL) divergence. Then, based on the achievable transmission rate and KL divergence, we propose an optimization framework for the integrated waveform parameter to achieve a tradeoff between the communication performance and sensing performance under peak power constraint. Finally, we conduct JCAS experiments under short distance of 1 m and long distance of 7 m. Both numerical and experimental results validate the balance between the sensing and communication performance. To the best of our knowledge, this is the first time that the waveform design for joint communication and target detection is proposed and experimentally verified.

With the help of pulse-shaping and channel equalization, PAM-based integrated waveforms can achieve a lower average BER than OFDM-based ones at high symbol rates [36]. For MIMO-based integrated waveforms, the optimization objective is typically formulated as a high-dimensional matrix optimization problem, which requires more sophisticated data processing than PAM-based ones [8]. Therefore, the PAM-based integrated waveform is simpler and easier to realize with the consideration of system performance and data processing complexity.

The remainder of this article is organized as follows. In Section II, we describe the JCAS system, present the communication and sensing problems, and offer the integrated waveform design scheme. In Section III, we analyze the relationships between the performance metrics and the integrated waveform parameter and provide the optimization criterion for integrated waveform parameter. Numerical and experimental results are presented in Sections IV and V, respectively. Finally, Section VI concludes this article.

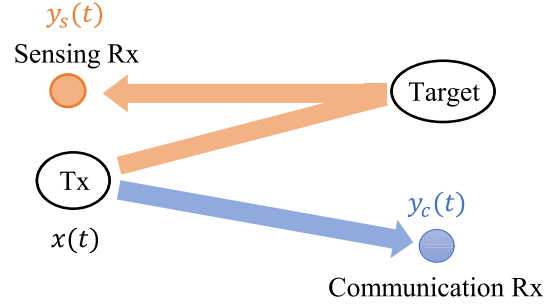


Fig. 1. Diagram of JCAS system.

II. SYSTEM MODEL

Fig. 1 illustrates a JCAS system based on visible light, where the integrated optical signal $x(t)$ is transmitted from a light source (e.g., LED) for both communication and sensing. The optical signal is received by the communication detector to convey the messages, and the received signal is denoted as $y_c(t)$. Meanwhile, the optical signal is reflected by the target and detected by the sensing detector, whose received signal is denoted as $y_s(t)$. In this work, we assume that M -PAM is adopted for JCAS, i.e., $x(t) \in \mathcal{S} = \{A_0, A_1, \dots, A_{M-1}\}$, where $\mathcal{S}$ denotes the constellation set. Because the indoor visible channel exhibits slow fading characteristics [37], we assume that the channel gain remains constant during one symbol period.

A. Communication Link

Define $x_n = x(nT_s)$ with $1/T_s$ being the sampling rate. The samples of $y_c(t)$ is given by

$$y_{c,n} = y_c(nT_s) = h_c x_n + w_{c,n}, n = 1, 2, \dots, N \quad (1)$$

where N denotes the number of samples, h_c denotes the communication link gain, and $w_{c,n} \sim \mathcal{N}(0, \sigma_c^2)$ denotes the additive Gaussian noise in the communication link.

The communication receiver needs to decide among the M possible symbols in set $\mathcal{S}$. We adopt the minimum error probability criterion for symbol detection, which is equivalent to the following minimum distance criterion:

$$\hat{x}_n = \arg \min_{x_n \in \mathcal{S}} \|y_{c,n} - h_c x_n\|. \quad (2)$$

B. Sensing Link

Define the samples of $y_s(t)$ as $y_{s,n} \triangleq y_s(nT_s)$. The sensing problem is to distinguish between the hypotheses with and without the target, i.e.,

$$\begin{aligned} \mathcal{H}_0 : y_{s,n} &= w_{s,0n}, n = 1, 2, \dots, N \\ \mathcal{H}_1 : y_{s,n} &= h_s x_n + w_{s,1n}, n = 1, 2, \dots, N \end{aligned} \quad (3)$$

where h_s denotes the sensing link gain, $w_{s,0n} \sim \mathcal{N}(0, \sigma_{s0}^2)$ and $w_{s,1n} \sim \mathcal{N}(0, \sigma_{s1}^2)$ denote the additive Gaussian noises in the sensing link.

The miss detection probability and false alarm probability are defined as

$$P_{md} = \Pr\{\mathcal{H}_0 | \mathcal{H}_1\}, P_{fa} = \Pr\{\mathcal{H}_1 | \mathcal{H}_0\}. \quad (4)$$

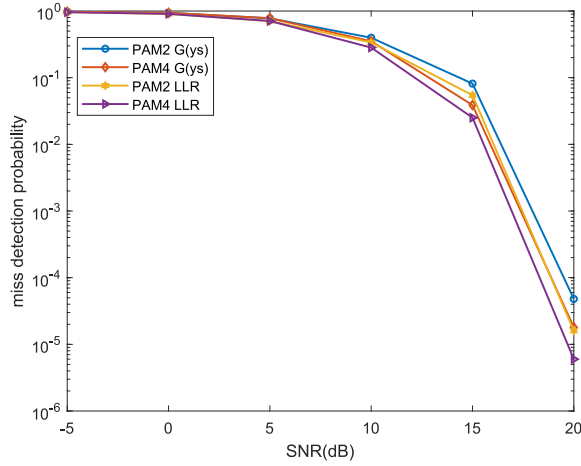


Fig. 2. Pmd versus SNR based on LR and $G(y_s)$ detection rules.

Adopting Neyman–Pearson (NP) criterion [38], we design the detection rule to minimize the miss detection probability P_{md} given that the false alarm probability P_{fa} does not exceed a threshold ϵ , i.e.,

$$\min P_{md}, \text{ s.t. } P_{fa} \leq \epsilon. \quad (5)$$

As $y_{s,n}$ under hypothesis $\mathcal{H}_1$ satisfies the mixed Gaussian distribution with probability density function (PDF)

$$p(y_{s,n}|\mathcal{H}_1) = \frac{1}{M} \sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}\sigma_{s1}} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_{s,n} - h_s A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right] \quad (6)$$

the optimal detection rule based on likelihood ratio (LR) in (7) involves high computational complexity [39]

$$L(y_s) = \frac{p(y_s|\mathcal{H}_0)}{p(y_s|\mathcal{H}_1)} = \frac{\prod_{n=1}^N \sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}M\sigma_{s1}} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_{s,n} - \mu_{sm})^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]}{\left(\frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}\sigma_{s0}}\right)^{N/2} \exp\left[-\sum_{n=1}^N \frac{y_{s,n}^2}{2\sigma_{s0}^2}\right]} \quad (7)$$

where $\mu_{sm} = h_s A_m$ and $y_s = [y_{s,1}, y_{s,2}, \dots, y_{s,N}]$.

Define $G(y_s) = \sum_{n=1}^N (y_{s,n}^2/\sigma_{s0}^2)$. In this work, a low-complexity detection rule based on test statistic $G(y_s)$ is proposed as

$$G(y_s) = \sum_{n=1}^N \frac{y_{s,n}^2}{\sigma_{s0}^2} \underset{\mathcal{H}_0}{\overset{\mathcal{H}_1}{\geq}} \gamma \quad (8)$$

where the threshold γ is determined by

$$P_{fa} = \Pr\{G(y_s) > \gamma | \mathcal{H}_0\} = \epsilon. \quad (9)$$

We compare the miss detection probability based on LR with that based on $G(y_s)$ under a single sample. It can be seen from Fig. 2 that the $G(y_s)$ -based detection rule has a certain performance loss compared to the LR-based one, but its computational complexity is lower even with multiple samples. Thus, it is reasonable and effective to adopt $G(y_s)$ as the test statistic.

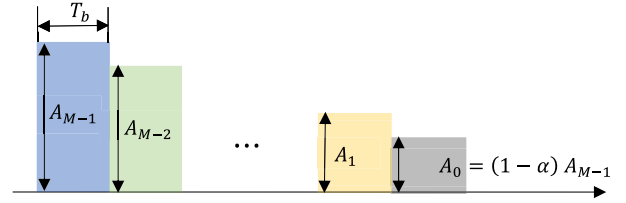


Fig. 3. Schematic of integrated waveform design.

C. Integrated Waveform Design

The detection rule for communication link shows that larger amplitude difference between symbols can improve the communication performance, while for sensing link, higher mean power of symbols can improve the sensing performance. Under the peak power constraint of the transmitter, there exists a fundamental tradeoff between larger amplitude difference and higher mean power of transmitted symbols.

For PAM-based JCAS system, the main objective of integrated waveform design is to find a balance between larger difference of symbol amplitudes $\{A_0, A_1, \dots, A_{M-1}\}$ and higher mean power. Considering the peak power constraint of the transmitter, we fix amplitude A_{M-1} to the peak power, and change other $M-1$ amplitudes through the parameter α , i.e.,

$$A_0 = (1 - \alpha)A_{M-1}, \alpha \in (0, 1]$$

$$A_m = A_{m-1} + \delta, \delta = \frac{\alpha A_{M-1}}{M-1}, m = 1, \dots, M-2 \quad (10)$$

and the corresponding schematic of the integrated waveform design is shown in Fig. 3.

As the parameter α increases, the amplitude difference δ increases, improving the communication performance. Meanwhile, an increase of α leads to a reduction in the mean symbol power, which deteriorates the sensing performance. Therefore, a good tradeoff between the communication performance and sensing performance can be achieved by choosing an appropriate value of α .

III. PERFORMANCE METRICS AND WAVEFORM DESIGN CRITERION

A. Communication Performance Metric

1) *SER*: For M -PAM signal, the SER is given by [40]

$$\begin{aligned} P_e &= \frac{2(M-1)}{M} \left\{ Q\left[\frac{h_c(A_{M-1} - A_0)}{2\sigma_c(M-1)}\right] \right\} \\ &= \frac{2(M-1)}{M} \left[Q\left(\frac{h_c\delta}{2\sigma_c}\right) \right] \end{aligned} \quad (11)$$

where $Q(x) = \int_x^{+\infty} (1/\sqrt{2\pi})e^{-(t^2/2)}dt$.

According to (11), P_e decreases with δ and α .

2) *Achievable Transmission Rate*: The achievable transmission rate between the input and output of the communication link is given by [41]

$$I(x_n; y_{c,n}) = h(y_{c,n}) - h(y_{c,n}|x_n). \quad (12)$$

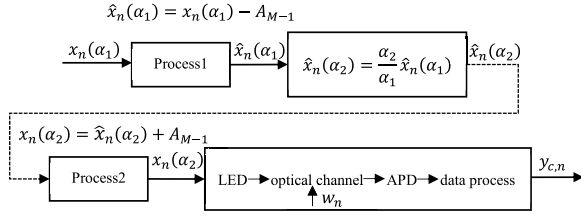


Fig. 4. Data transmission process in optical channel.

Note that $y_{c,n}$ obeys a mixed Gaussian distribution with PDF [42]

$$p(y_{c,n}) = \frac{1}{M} \sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}\sigma_c} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_{c,n} - h_c A_m)^2}{2\sigma_c^2}\right]. \quad (13)$$

According to (12) and (13), the achievable transmission rate is a function of signal amplitudes, which are given by $A_m = A_{m-1} + (\alpha A_{M-1}/M - 1)$ and related to α . For notational simplicity, we express the achievable transmission rate as a function of α

$$I(\alpha) \triangleq I(x_n(\alpha); y_{c,n}), x_n(\alpha) \in A_{M-1}S(\alpha) \\ S(\alpha) = \left\{1 - \alpha, 1 - \frac{M-2}{M-1}\alpha, \dots, 1 - \frac{1}{M-1}\alpha, 1\right\}. \quad (14)$$

As shown in the following theorem, $I(\alpha)$ is an increasing function of α .

Theorem 1: Given M and A_{M-1} , $I(\alpha)$ increases with α , i.e.,

$$\forall \alpha_1 < \alpha_2, I(\alpha_1) < I(\alpha_2). \quad (15)$$

Proof: Consider the data transmission process in optical channel in Fig. 4, where $\alpha_1 < \alpha_2$, and $x_n(\alpha_k) = A_{M-1}S(\alpha_k)$, $k \in \{1, 2\}$.

As $x_n(\alpha_1)$, $\hat{x}_n(\alpha_1)$, $\hat{x}_n(\alpha_2)$, $x_n(\alpha_2)$, and $y_{c,n}$ form a Markov chain $x_n(\alpha_1) \rightarrow \hat{x}_n(\alpha_1) \rightarrow \hat{x}_n(\alpha_2) \rightarrow x_n(\alpha_2) \rightarrow y_{c,n}$ [43], we have $I(x_n(\alpha_1); y_{c,n}) \leq I(x_n(\alpha_2); y_{c,n})$ by data processing inequality. ■

B. Sensing Performance Metric

1) *Miss Detection Probability:* According to the central limit theorem, $(1/N)G(\mathbf{y}_s)$ approximately follows Gaussian distribution under both hypotheses $\mathcal{H}_0$ and $\mathcal{H}_1$ [44], i.e.,

$$\mathcal{H}_0 : \frac{1}{N}G(\mathbf{y}_s) \sim \mathcal{N}(\sigma_{s0}^2, 2\sigma_{s0}^4) \\ \mathcal{H}_1 : \frac{1}{N}G(\mathbf{y}_s) \sim \mathcal{N}(\mu, \sigma^2) \quad (16)$$

where μ and σ are given by

$$\mu = \frac{\sum_{m=0}^{M-1} (\sigma_{s1}^2 + \mu_{sm}^2)}{M\sigma_{s0}^2} \\ \sigma^2 = \frac{3\sigma_{s1}^4 + \sum_{m=0}^{M-1} (5\sigma_{s1}^2 \mu_{sm}^2 + \mu_{sm}^4)}{MN\sigma_{s0}^4} - \frac{\left[\sigma_{s1}^2 + \sum_{m=0}^{M-1} (\mu_{sm}^2)\right]^2}{M^2N\sigma_{s0}^4}. \quad (17)$$

We analyze the sensing performance based on (16). Given the false alarm probability $P_{fa} = \epsilon$, detection threshold γ , and the miss detection probability P_{md} are given by [38]

$$\gamma = Q^{-1}(P_{fa})\sqrt{2N\sigma_{s0}^4} + N\sigma_{s0}^2 \quad (18)$$

$$P_{md} = \int_{-\infty}^{\gamma} P(G|\mathcal{H}_1)dG = 1 - Q\left[\frac{\gamma - \mu}{\sigma}\right]. \quad (19)$$

It can be seen from (19) that P_{md} decreases with μ , which is proportional to $\{A_m\}_{m=0}^{M-1}$, and $\{A_m\}_{m=0}^{M-1}$ vary with α from (10). Thus, P_{md} increases with the α .

2) *KL Divergence:* According to the law of Chernoff–Stein given by (20), KL divergence characterizes the exponential coefficient of miss detection probability as the samples size approaches infinity [45], which serves as the extreme performance of sensing. Thus, we can also adopt KL divergence to characterize the sensing performance [46]

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \frac{\log P_{md}}{N} = -D(p_{s0}(y_s)||p_{s1}(y_s)) \\ = \int p_{s0}(y_s) \log \frac{p_{s0}(y_s)}{p_{s1}(y_s)} dy_s \quad (20)$$

where $p_{s1}(y_s)$ is the PDF of a mixed Gaussian distribution under hypothesis $\mathcal{H}_1$, whose parameters can be estimated by expectation–maximization (EM) algorithm.

From (20), we can see that the KL divergence is determined by $p_{s1}(y_s)$ and $p_{s0}(y_s)$, where $p_{s0}(y_s)$ is independent of α , $p_{s1}(y_s)$ is related to signal amplitudes, which are given by $A_m = A_{m-1} + (\alpha A_{M-1}/M - 1)$ and related to α . Therefore, we can prove that $D(p_{s0}(y_s)||p_{s1}(y_s))$ is decreasing with respect to α . We prove a stronger conclusion that the KL divergence is increasing with respect to all A_i for $0 \leq i \leq M-2$, as stated in the following theorem.

Theorem 2: Given M and A_{M-1} , KL divergence $D(p_{s0}(y_s)||p_{s1}(y_s))$ increases with A_i , $i \in \{0, 1, \dots, M-2\}$, i.e.,

$$\forall A_i, i \in \{0, 1, \dots, M-2\} \\ \frac{\partial D(p_{s0}(y_s)||p_{s1}(y_s, A_0, A_1, \dots, A_{M-1}))}{\partial A_i} > 0. \quad (21)$$

Proof: See Appendix A. ■

C. Modulation Design Criterion

We provide the modulation design criterion based on achievable transmission rate and KL divergence. The modulation design criterion based on SER and miss detection probability is similar and will not be described. We optimize the modulation constellation to maximize the KL divergence, provided that the achievable transmission rate is no less than a certain threshold. Note that the highest amplitude peak power. Therefore, we actually need to optimize other $M-1$ amplitudes $\{A_m\}_{m=0}^{M-2}$ by adjusting parameter α . The optimization problem can be formulated as

$$\max_{\alpha} D(p_{s0}(y_s)||p_{s1}(y_s)) \\ \text{s.t. } I(\alpha) \geq I_{th}, \alpha \in (0, 1] \\ A_0 = (1 - \alpha)A_{M-1} \\ A_m = A_{m-1} + \frac{\alpha A_{M-1}}{M-1}, m = 1, \dots, M-2. \quad (22)$$

In problem (22), the objective function $D(p_{s0}(y_s)||p_{s1}(y_s))$ decreases with α , while the achievable transmission rate $I(\alpha)$ in the constraint is an increasing function of α . As a result, the optimal solution α^* to problem (22) must satisfy $I(\alpha^*) = I_{th}$, i.e., $\alpha^* = I^{-1}(I_{th})$, which is a function of communication link gain h_c , not related to sensing link gain h_s .

IV. NUMERICAL EVALUATIONS

In this section, we first verify the relationship between the performance metrics and the integrated waveform parameter α at different signal-to-noise ratios (SNRs) and different PAM orders to ensure the accuracy of the theoretical analysis in Sections III-A and III-B. Then, the tradeoff between the communication performance and sensing performance is analyzed, and the effect of PAM orders on sensing performances are provided.

A. Parameter Settings

Assuming negligible reflection from the walls, communication and sensing in the JCAS system are achieved through line-of-sight (LOS) link and first-order non-LOS (NLOS) link, respectively.

Let x denote the electrical signal at the transmitter, which is converted to the optical signal by the LED. After passing through the channel, the optical signal is received by the avalanche photodiode (APD) and converted to an electrical signal, i.e.,

$$P_r = \eta h P_t = \eta h \kappa x \quad (23)$$

where $P_t = \kappa x$ denotes the transmitted optical power, κ denotes the electrical-to-optical conversion coefficient of the LED, h denotes the channel gain, η denotes the optical-to-electrical conversion coefficient of the APD, and P_r denotes the received optical power.

Consider an LED transmitter with a Lambertian emission pattern, as shown in Fig. 5. The channel gain in the communication link is given by [47]

$$h_c = \begin{cases} \frac{A(m+1)}{2\pi d^2} \cos^m(\varphi_c) \cos(\psi_c), & 0 \leq \psi_c \leq \Psi \\ 0, & \text{otherwise} \end{cases} \quad (24)$$

where $m = -\ln 2 / \ln(\cos \varphi_{1/2})$ is the order of Lambertian emission, $\varphi_{1/2}$ is the semi-angle of LED at half power, φ_c is the emission angle of LED in the communication link, d is the distance between the LED and communication receiver, A is the effective area of the APD, ψ_c is the incidence angle at the communication receiver, and Ψ is the field of view (FOV) of the APD.

In the sensing link, for a target with distance d_1 from the transmitter and d_2 from the receiver, the channel gain is given by [47]

$$h_s = \begin{cases} \frac{A(m+1)}{2\pi d_1^2 d_2^2} \rho A_r \cos^m(\varphi_s) \cos(\beta_i) \cos(\beta_r), & 0 \leq \psi_s \leq \Psi \\ 0, & \text{otherwise} \end{cases} \quad (25)$$

where φ_s is the emission angle of LED in the sensing link, ρ is the reflectance coefficient of the target, A_r is the micro-element of the reflective area, β_i and β_r are the incidence angle

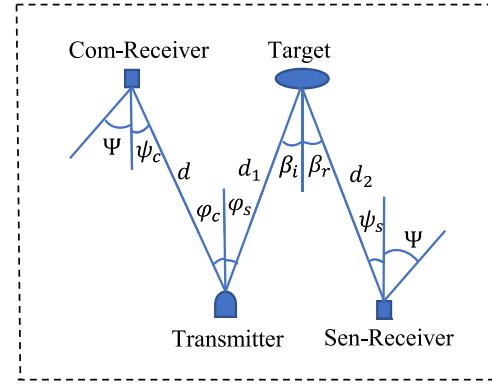


Fig. 5. Geometric models of LOS link and NLOS link.

TABLE I
TYPICAL PARAMETERS OF LOS LINK AND NLOS LINK

Radiation power	1 W
Semi-angle of LED at half-power	60°
Reflection coefficient	0.5
Reflective area of the target	1 m × 1 m
Effective area of the APD	3 mm
FOV of the APD	70°
Vertical distance between transmitter and receiver planes	1 m

and radiation angle at the target, respectively, and ψ_s is the incidence angle at the sensing receiver.

According to the device manual of the APD used in the experiment, η is 22 (A/W) at multiplication factor 50 and wavelength 550 nm. From [48] and [49], the false alarm probability P_{fa} is set to 0.01, and the miss detection probability below 0.01 represents satisfactory sensing performance. The symbol peak amplitude A_{M-1} is set to 10, and A_0 varies from 0 to 8 with a step size of 2. The set of discrete points of α is {0.2, 0.4, 0.6, 0.8, 1} according to the formula $A_0 = (1 - \alpha)A_{M-1}$. SNR varies from 0 to 30 dB with a step size of 5 dB. The typical parameters in the geometric models of the LOS link and the NLOS link are shown in Table I [50].

B. Numerical Results

The achievable transmission rate and KL divergence versus SNRs for 4-PAM signal are shown in Fig. 6. It can be observed that the achievable rate increases with α and the KL divergence decreases with α , which are consistent with the monotonicity of the theoretical analysis. Moreover, both the communication performance and sensing performance are improved as the SNR increases. The similar analysis can be performed on SER and P_{md} versus SNR for 4-PAM signal.

With SNR fixed to a certain value, e.g., 20 dB, we can obtain $h_c=3.7081e-4$, $h_s=9.1587e-5$, $\sigma_c=3.301e-4$, and $\sigma_s=8.153e-5$. Fig. 7 plots the SER and P_{md} versus α under different PAM orders, and Fig. 8 plots the achievable transmission rate and KL divergence versus α under different PAM orders. It can be seen from Figs. 7 and 8 that the balance between the communication performance and sensing performance can be achieved through the parameter α .

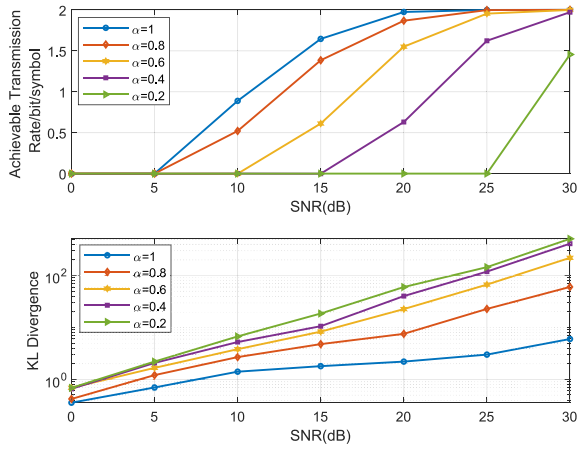


Fig. 6. Achievable transmission rate and KL divergence for 4-PAM.

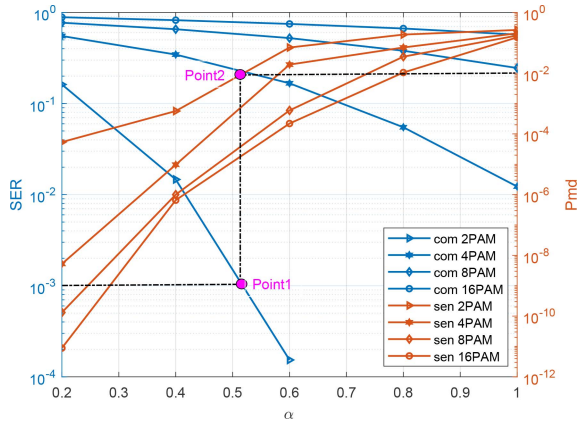


Fig. 7. BER and miss detection probability versus α under different PAM orders.

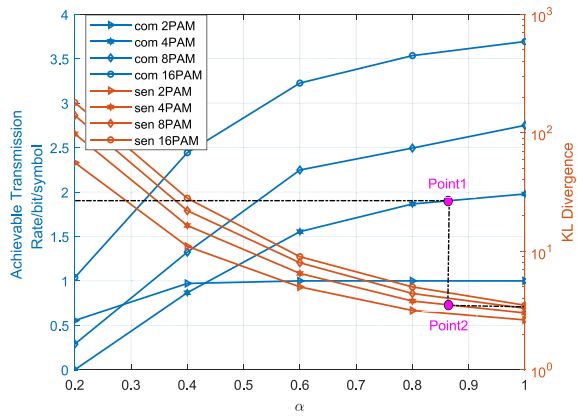


Fig. 8. Achievable transmission rate and KL divergence versus α under different PAM orders.

From “Point1” and “Point2” in Fig. 7, we have $\alpha^* = 0.52$ and the corresponding $P_{md} = 10^{-2}$ for 2-PAM signal and SER threshold of 10^{-3} . If α falls below α^* , the communication performance deteriorates with an increase in SER, and the sensing performance improves with a decrease in P_{md} . If α rises above α^* , the opposite trends can be observed. From Point1 and Point2 in Fig. 8, we have $\alpha^* = 0.86$ and the corresponding KL divergence of 2.5 for 4-PAM signal and

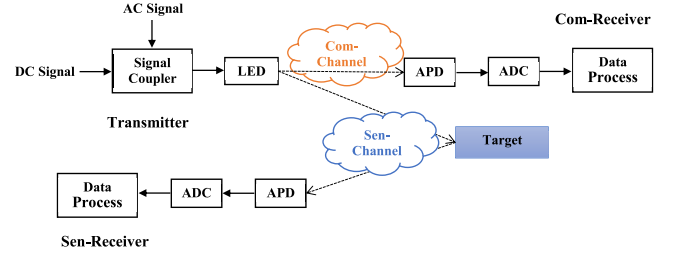


Fig. 9. Block diagram of the experimental system.

$I_{th} = 1.9$. If α falls below α^* , the communication performance deteriorates with a decrease in achievable data rate, and the sensing performance improves with an increase in KL divergence. If α rises above α^* , the opposite trends can be observed. Similarly, α^* can be obtained for other PAM orders.

Moreover, the numerical results indicate that the better sensing performance can be obtained for high-order PAM signals, mainly due to the fact that high-order PAM signals shows lower tail probability to the value around zero compared with that of low-order PAM signals.

V. EXPERIMENTAL EVALUATIONS

In this section, we experimentally investigate the effect of the integrated waveform on the communication performance and sensing performance when detection target is within 1 and 7 m from the LED. The block diagram of the experimental system is shown in Fig. 9.

A. Experimental Settings

1) *Short Distance Case*: The experimental system is shown in Fig. 10. A green LED (Cree XPG2) is driven by a Bias-Tee. The direct current (DC) is driven by a DC power supply (Rigol DP832A), and the PAM signal (1 MSa/s) is generated by an arbitrary waveform generator (Keysight 33600A). The light beam angle is approximately 41.2° , so that the spot size is comparable to the area of the target, thus maximizing the intensity of the received signals. The detection target and communication receiver are both 1 m from the LED, representing the short distance case.

2) *Long Distance Case*: The experimental scene is basically the same as the short distance case, but the difference is that the light source is changed to a blue LED (Cree XHP70) with higher power. A PMMA plano-convex lens with diameter of 35 mm and height of 8.7 mm is employed to converge the light. As shown in Fig. 11, the detection target and communication receiver are 7 and 6 m away from the LED, respectively, which represents the long distance case.

In this work, two detection materials are measured, a down jacket and a hospital gown, both of which have an approximate reflective area of 1 square meter. Both materials reflect diffusely when the light irradiates the surface, but the diffuse reflection of the hospital gown is more serious due to its rougher surface, which leads to a longer detection time.

At the transmitter, we change the voltage of both alternate current (AC) and DC component to keep the peak amplitude

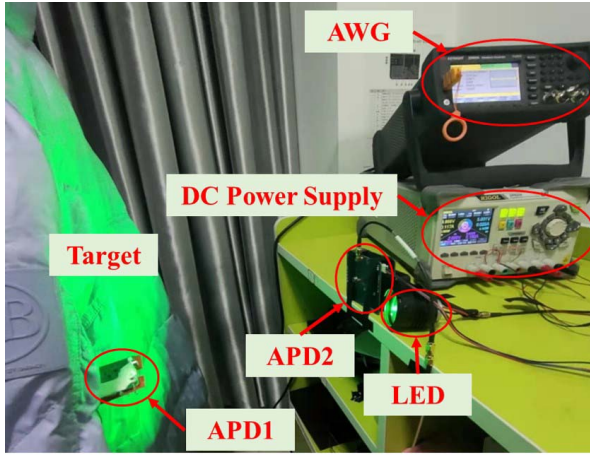


Fig. 10. Experimental system for JCAS at short distance.

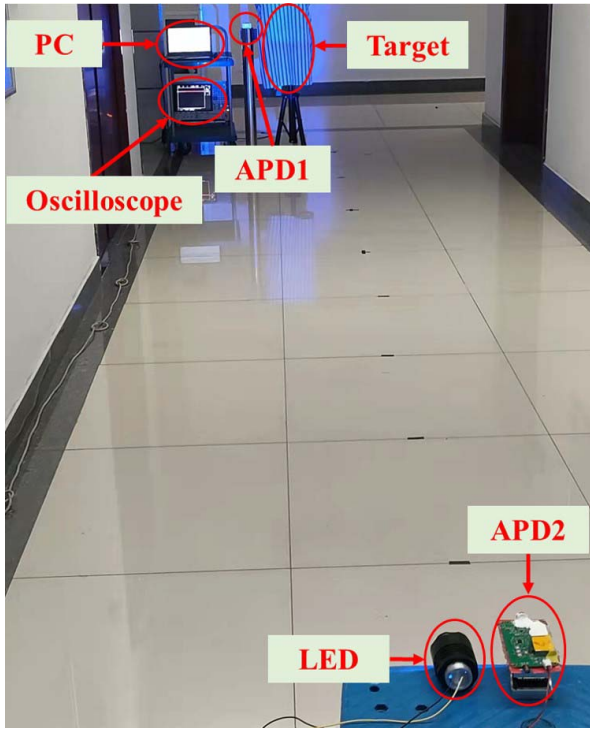


Fig. 11. Experimental scene for JCAS at long distance.

A_{M-1} on the LED constant while varying the amplitudes $\{A_m\}_{m=0}^{M-2}$. However, due to the nonlinearity of the LED's photoelectric conversion, DC decreases with unequal steps when AC increases equally. Therefore, we set DC values according to the approximate constant maximum value of the received signal under different AC values. In addition, for different AC and DC settings, we calculate the values of α based on the maximum and minimum values of the received signal. The values of α at different AC and DC settings are presented in Table II.

Because the measurement of the optical power at the transmitter is relatively complicated, we set the DC values based on the maximum value of the received signal rather than the maximum optical power of the transmitted signal for different AC values.

TABLE II
VALUES OF α FOR DIFFERENT ACS AND DCs

AC(V)		2	4	6	8	10
Short Distance	DC(V)	3.01	2.97	2.9	2.8	2.7
	α	0.1928	0.2574	0.3554	0.4903	0.5576
Long Distance	DC(V)	6.1	5.8	5.6	5.5	5
	α	0.8046	0.8365	0.8485	0.8851	0.9209

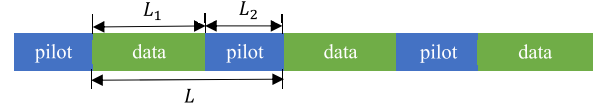


Fig. 12. Transmitted frame structure with synchronization pilot.

At the receiver side, one APD (Hamamatsu C12702-12) with DC filtering, denoted as APD1, is adopted for communication. Another APD (Hamamatsu S5344) without DC filtering, denoted as APD2, is adopted to detect the reflected signals from the target. Furthermore, an oscilloscope (Agilent MSOX6004A) is adopted to capture and save the sampled signals of APD1 and APD2 at a sampling rate of 10 MSa/s for offline data processing on the computer.

B. Data Processing

In the offline processing stage, we adopt the digital bandpass filter to remove the high-frequency noise of the devices and the low-frequency noise of indoor LEDs. Then perform the parameters estimation and performances calculation based on specific data of the frame structure in Fig. 12, where the frame structure has a “pilot” length of 256 symbols and a ratio of pilot length to “data” length of 1/127.

In the communication link, pilot sequences and data sequences are adopted for synchronization and performances calculation, respectively. The length of the synchronization pilot needs to be determined based on the specific scenario, signal characteristics, and noise level. While in the sensing link, pilot sequences and data sequences are not distinguished.

1) *Estimation for Communication*: The communication channel gain can be estimated by the pilot sequences according to maximum-likelihood estimation (MLE) method [51], i.e.,

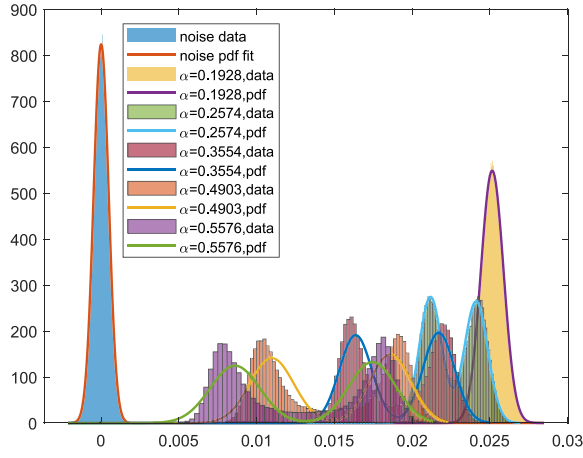
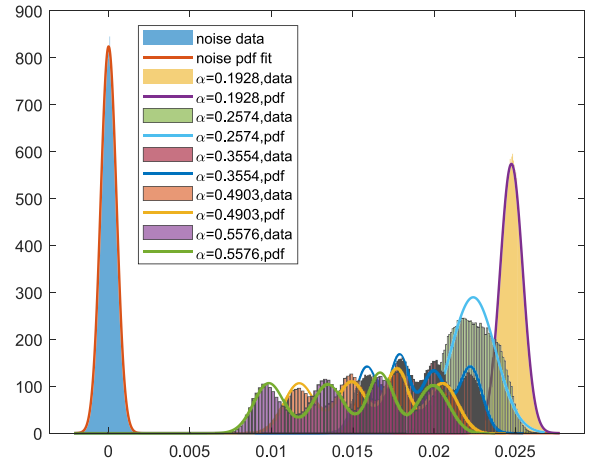
$$\hat{h}_c = \arg \max_{h_c} \ln p(\mathbf{y}_c^p | h_c) = \arg \min_{h_c} \sum_{n=1}^{L_2} (y_{c,n}^p - h_c x_n)^2 \quad (26)$$

where $\mathbf{y}_c^p$ denotes the received samples corresponding to the pilot sequences with dimension L_2 .

By setting the derivative of $\ln p(\mathbf{y}_c^p | h_c)$ with respect to h_c to be zero, the MLE of h_c can be obtained as

$$\hat{h}_c = \frac{\sum_{n=1}^{L_2} x_n y_{c,n}^p}{\sum_{n=1}^{L_2} x_n^2} \quad (27)$$

2) *Estimation for Sensing*: The mean and variance of Gaussian distribution under hypothesis $\mathcal{H}_0$ are estimated by

Fig. 13. Distributions of sample values and the PDFs versus α for 2-PAM.Fig. 14. Sample distributions and the PDFs versus α for 4-PAM.

MLE method [51], i.e.,

$$\hat{\mu}_{s0} = \arg \max_{\mu_{s0}} p(\mathbf{y}_s | \mathcal{H}_0) = \frac{1}{N} \sum_{n=1}^N y_{s,n} \quad (28)$$

$$\hat{\sigma}_{s0}^2 = \arg \max_{\sigma_{s0}^2} p(\mathbf{y}_s | \mathcal{H}_0) = \sqrt{\frac{1}{N} \sum_{n=1}^N y_{s,n}^2}. \quad (29)$$

Note that the sample under hypothesis $\mathcal{H}_1$ follows a mixed Gaussian distribution, as given in (6), whose parameters are estimated by adopting EM algorithm. The detailed process is given in [52, Appendix B].

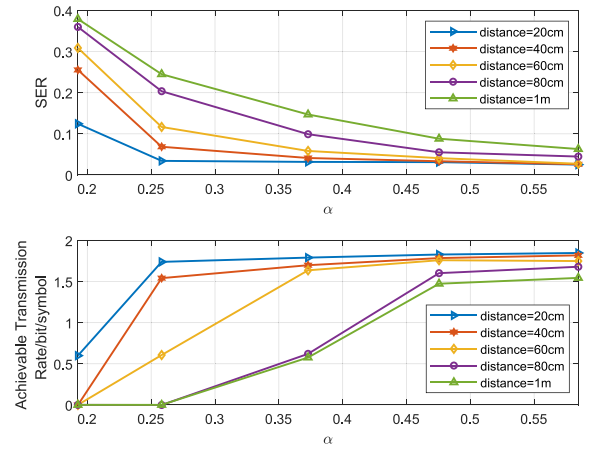
Finally, we adopt the estimated parameters and filtered signals to evaluate the communication and sensing performances. A sliding-window is adopted to calculate the correlation values between the synchronization pilot to obtain the “start” position of a frame, followed by the symbol detection based on the estimates. For sensing, the PDF under hypothesis $\mathcal{H}_0$ and $\mathcal{H}_1$ are obtained from the estimated parameters.

C. Experimental Results

Figs. 13 and 14 plot the distributions of the sample values and the corresponding PDFs for 2-PAM and 4-PAM signals under different α at a distance of 20 cm, where the “noise pdf” denotes the PDF under hypothesis $\mathcal{H}_0$, and the “ $\alpha = m$ pdf” represents the PDF under $\mathcal{H}_1$ with $\alpha = m$.

We mean originally that as α increases, the interval between the two peaks of the PDF under $\mathcal{H}_1$ increases, resulting in a lower SER. Meanwhile, the PDF under $\mathcal{H}_1$ gets closer to that under $\mathcal{H}_0$, leading to higher miss detection probability. Thus, we can conclude that the communication performance and sensing performance follow an opposite trend with α .

The SER and achievable rate with respect to α at different distances for 4-PAM signal are shown in Fig. 15. It can be seen that the SER decreases with α and the achievable transmission rate increase with α , which is consistent with the results of the theoretical analyses in Section III-A. In addition, due to the constant beam angle of the LED, the channel gain of the communication link decreases with distance, thus

Fig. 15. SER and achievable transmission rate versus α for 4-PAM signal.

the SNR decreases and the communication performances are weakened.

Based on the threshold and 10-ms observations, P_{md} and KL divergence with respect to α for 4-PAM signals are shown in Fig. 16. We can still obtain results consistent with the theoretical analyses that P_{md} decreases with α and KL divergence increases with α . Moreover, the sensing performances deteriorate with the distance because of the reduced mean received power.

We compare the communication performance and sensing performance at distances of 80 cm and 1 m, including SER and miss detection probability P_{md} , the achievable rate and KL divergence, as shown in Figs. 17 and 18. The miss detection probability is calculated based on forty milliseconds of received samples. From the results, we can conclude that the tradeoff between the communication performance and the sensing performance can be achieved through the selection of parameter α . The optimal α is obtained based on the requirement of communication performance.

Next, we investigate the sensing performance over longer distance of 7 m under 2-PAM signal. Due to strong reflection of the walls, we increase the observation time when detecting the target, and calculate the miss detection probability based on the observed samples of 200 ms.

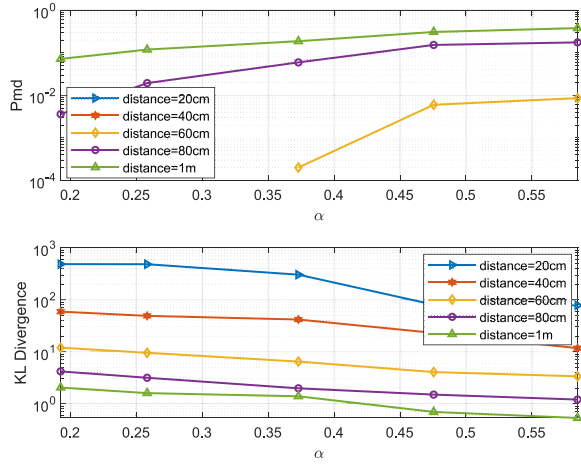


Fig. 16. Miss detection probability and KL divergence versus α for 4-PAM signal.

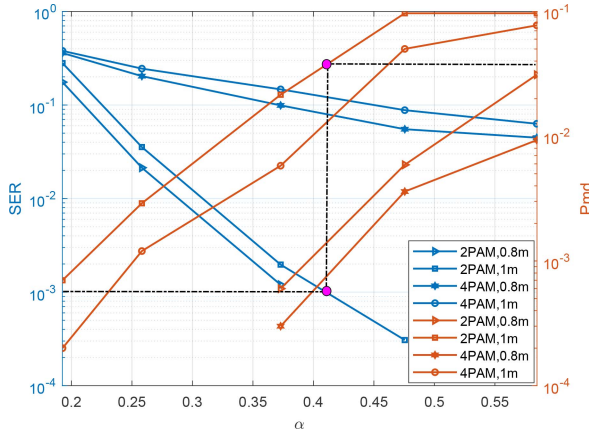


Fig. 17. SER and miss detection probability versus α for different PAM orders.

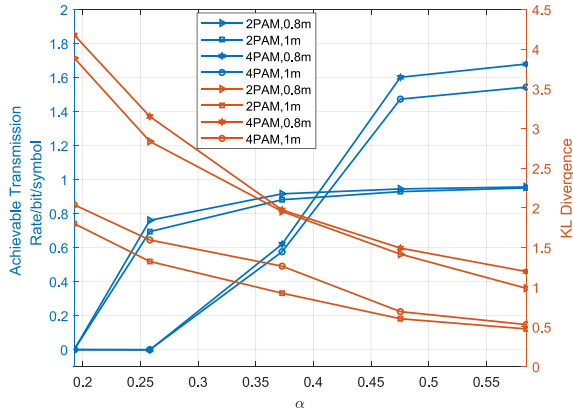


Fig. 18. Achievable transmission rate and KL divergence versus α for different PAM orders.

The sample distributions and the PDFs versus α for different reflectors are shown in Fig. 19. Due to the long distance, the PDF under hypothesis $\mathcal{H}_1$ obey a Gaussian distribution rather than a mixed Gaussian distribution. As α increases, the PDF under $\mathcal{H}_1$ yields more overlap with the PDF under $\mathcal{H}_0$, which increases the miss detection probability and deteriorates the sensing performance.

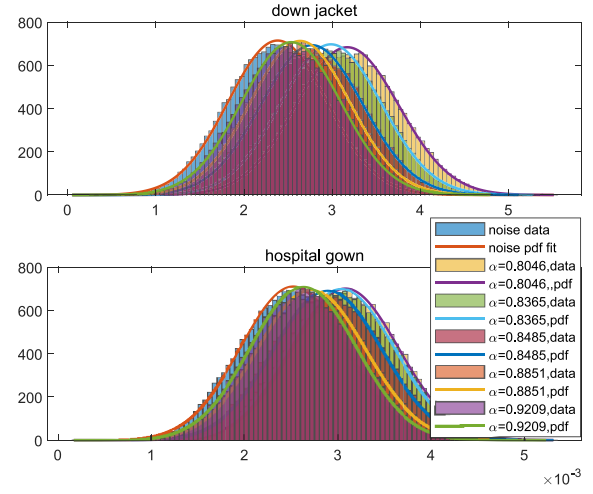


Fig. 19. Samples distributions and the PDFs versus α for different reflectors.

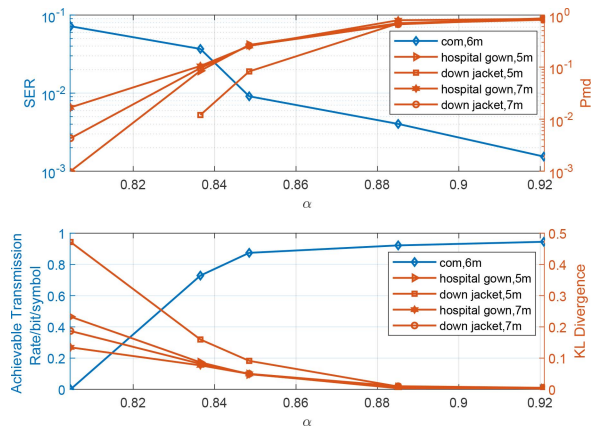


Fig. 20. Communication and sensing performance versus α .

Fig. 20 plots the performances of communication and sensing versus α . The sensing performances are poorer than those of the down jacket because of the stronger diffuse reflection of the hospital gown. The balance between the communication performance and sensing performance in the long range case also can be achieved through parameter α .

VI. CONCLUSION

In this article, we have explored the integrated communication and sensing waveform design for PAM signal based on visible light. The SER, the achievable transmission rate, the miss detection probability and KL divergence have been adopted as the performance metrics. An optimization criterion with respect to parameter of the integrated waveform under peak power constraint have been proposed. We have conducted the JCAS experiments for objects under short distance of 1 m and long distance of 7 m. Numerical and experimental results have demonstrated the performance tradeoff between communication and sensing. With longer distances and stronger diffuse reflections, the sample size for target detection needs to be increased to obtain better sensing performance. In addition, under the same sampling rate and the same number of samples for target detection, high-order PAM signals provide better

sensing performance due to the lower tail probability to the value around zero.

APPENDIX

A. Proof of Theorem 2

The KL divergence can be calculated as

$$D(p_{s0}||p_{s1}) = \frac{1}{2} \ln \frac{\sigma_{s1}^2}{e\sigma_{s0}^2} - \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}\sigma_{s0}} \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} \exp\left(\frac{y_s^2}{2\sigma_{s0}^2}\right) \ln \left\{ \sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_s - h_s A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right] \right\} dy_s. \quad (30)$$

We set channel link gain h_s to be one to simplify the calculation and define

$$f(A_0, A_1, \dots, A_{M-1}) \triangleq \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} \exp\left[-\frac{y_s^2}{2\sigma_{s0}^2}\right] \ln \left\{ \sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_s - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right] \right\} dy_s. \quad (31)$$

For any $A_i, i \in \{0, 1, \dots, M-2\}$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{\partial f}{\partial A_i} &= \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} \exp\left[-\frac{y_s^2}{2\sigma_{s0}^2}\right] \frac{\exp\left[-\frac{(y_s - A_i)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right] \frac{y_s - A_i}{\sigma_{s1}^2}}{\sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_s - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]} dy_s \\ &= \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} \exp\left[-\frac{y_s^2 + A_i^2}{2\sigma_{s0}^2} - \frac{y_s^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right] \frac{\exp\left[-\frac{y_s A_i}{\sigma_{s0}^2} - \frac{y_s}{\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]}{\sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_s + A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]} dy_s \\ &= \int_0^{\infty} \exp\left[-\frac{y_s^2 + A_i^2}{2\sigma_{s0}^2} - \frac{y_s^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right] \frac{\exp\left[-\frac{y_s A_i}{\sigma_{s0}^2} - \frac{y_s}{\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]}{\sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_s + A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]} dy_s \\ &\quad - \int_0^{\infty} \exp\left[-\frac{y_s^2 + A_i^2}{2\sigma_{s0}^2} - \frac{y_s^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right] \frac{\exp\left[\frac{y_s A_i}{\sigma_{s0}^2} - \frac{y_s}{\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]}{\sum_{m=0}^{M-1} \exp\left[-\frac{(y_s - A_i + A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}\right]} dy_s. \end{aligned} \quad (32)$$

For $y_s > 0$, we have

$$\frac{(y_s + A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2} - \frac{A_i y_s}{\sigma_{s0}^2} < \frac{y_s^2 - 2y_s A_m + (A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2} \quad (33)$$

$$\frac{(y_s - A_i + A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2} + \frac{A_i y_s}{\sigma_{s0}^2} > \frac{y_s^2 + 2y_s A_m + (A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2}. \quad (34)$$

Using (33) and (34), it yields

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{y_s^2 - 2y_s A_m + (A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2} &< \frac{y_s^2 + 2y_s A_m + (A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2} \\ \Rightarrow \frac{(y_s + A_i - A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2} - \frac{A_i y_s}{\sigma_{s0}^2} &< \frac{(y_s - A_i + A_m)^2}{2\sigma_{s1}^2} + \frac{A_i y_s}{\sigma_{s0}^2}. \end{aligned} \quad (35)$$

Combining (32) and (35), it follows that for any $A_i, i \in \{0, 1, \dots, M-2\}$, $(\partial f / \partial A_i) < 0$. Thus, $f(A_0, A_1, \dots, A_{M-1})$ decreases with A_i and KL divergence increases with $\{A_i\}_{i=0}^{M-2}$.

Algorithm 1 EM Algorithm Based on Initial Values Optimized

Input: samples $\mathbf{y}_s$, PAM order M , maximum iterations $Iter$, estimation error Err ;

Output: estimated means $\hat{\mu}_s$, estimated variances $\hat{\sigma}_s^2$;

```

1: Divide samples into  $T = 8M$  sections based on its value,
   i.e.,  $\mathbf{y}_s = [\mathbf{y}_{s1}, \mathbf{y}_{s2}, \dots, \mathbf{y}_{sT}]$ ;
2: Calculate the density  $d_i$ , mean value  $\mu_i$  of each section;
3: Initial  $i = 1, j = 1$  and  $temp = []$ ;
4: repeat
5:   if  $d_i < E\{\mathbf{d}\}$ ,  $\mu_i < E\{\mu\}$  then
6:      $temp = [temp; \mathbf{y}_{si}]$ ;
7:      $i = i + 1$ ;
8:   else
9:      $\mathbf{y}_{new,j} = temp$ ;
10:     $j = j + 1$ ;
11:     $temp = \mathbf{y}_{si}$ ;
12:     $i = i + 1$ ;
13:   end if
14: until  $(i < T)$ 
15:  $M = j - 1$ ;
16: for  $m \in [1, M]$  do
17:   Initialize  $\mu_{sm} = E\{\mathbf{y}_{new,m}\}$ ;
18:   Initialize  $\sigma_{sm}^2 = E\{\mathbf{y}_{new,m} - \mu_{sm}\}$ ;
19: end for
20: Set  $k = 1$ ;
21: repeat
22:   Compute  $E\{\hat{\eta}_m | \mathbf{y}_s, (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k\}$  as in Eq. (36);
23:   Update  $(\hat{\mu}_{sm})^{k+1}$  as in Eq. (37);
24:   Update  $(\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^{k+1}$  as in Eq. (38);
25:   if  $\|(\hat{\mu}_s)^{k+1} - (\hat{\mu}_s)^k\| < Err$ ,  $\|(\hat{\sigma}_s^2)^{k+1} - (\hat{\sigma}_s^2)^k\| < Err$ 
       then
26:     break;
27:   end if
28:    $k = k + 1$ ;
29: until  $(k > Iter)$ 

```

B. EM Algorithm

The detailed process of EM algorithm is shown in Algorithm 1. For the EM algorithm, we have

$$E\left\{\hat{\eta}_m | \mathbf{y}_s, (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k\right\} = \frac{\mathcal{N}(\mathbf{y}_s | (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k)}{\sum_m \mathcal{N}(\mathbf{y}_s | (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k)} \quad (36)$$

where $\hat{\eta}_m$ denotes the set of hidden variables estimated under Gaussian distribution with mean $\hat{\mu}_{sm}$ and variance $\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2$

$$(\hat{\mu}_{sm})^{k+1} = \frac{E\left\{\hat{\eta}_m | \mathbf{y}_s, (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k\right\} * \mathbf{y}_s^T}{\sum_m E\left\{\hat{\eta}_m | \mathbf{y}_s, (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k\right\}} \quad (37)$$

$$(\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^{k+1} = \frac{E\left\{\hat{\eta}_m | \mathbf{y}_s, (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k\right\} \cdot [\mathbf{y}_s^T - (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k]^2}{\sum_m E\left\{\hat{\eta}_m | \mathbf{y}_s, (\hat{\mu}_{sm})^k, (\hat{\sigma}_{sm}^2)^k\right\}}. \quad (38)$$

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